

Exon Research

Quantitative Models Reference Guide

Mathematical Models, Statistical Methods & Machine Learning
for Crypto, Equity & Options Trading

31 quantitative models across 6 asset-class modules

260 automated tests | Walk-forward validated

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1. Options Pricing Models

1.1 Black-Scholes Model

The foundational options pricing model derived by Fischer Black and Myron Scholes (1973). It prices European-style options by modelling the underlying as geometric Brownian motion under risk-neutral valuation. In Exon, this is the core engine for options backtesting (mark-to-market repricing every bar) and for estimating theoretical premiums when live market data is unavailable.

```
Call = S * N(d1) - K * exp(-rT) * N(d2)
Put = K * exp(-rT) * N(-d2) - S * N(-d1)
```

```
d1 = [ln(S/K) + (r + 0.5*v^2)*T] / (v*sqrt(T))
d2 = d1 - v*sqrt(T)
```

S=spot, K=strike, T=time to expiry (years), v=volatility, r=risk-free rate

Strengths:

- Closed-form solution: instant computation, no iteration needed
- Mathematically elegant with well-understood properties
- Foundation for all Greeks calculations
- Widely accepted as market standard for European options

Weaknesses:

- Assumes constant volatility (reality: volatility smile/skew)
- Assumes log-normal returns (reality: fat tails, jumps)
- European-style only (no early exercise modelling)
- Poor for deep OTM/ITM options and near expiry

Example: AAPL at \$150, strike \$155, 30 days to expiry, 25% IV, 5% rate: Call price = \$2.47 (mostly time value since OTM). If AAPL moves to \$160, BS reprices the call to ~\$7.30, capturing the delta-driven profit.

1.2 Greeks (Delta, Gamma, Theta, Vega, Rho)

The partial derivatives of the Black-Scholes price with respect to underlying parameters. Greeks quantify how option price changes when each input moves. In Exon, portfolio-level Greeks are tracked daily during backtesting to monitor risk exposure.

```
Delta = dV/dS (N(d1) for calls, N(d1)-1 for puts)
Gamma = d2V/dS2 (pdf(d1) / (S*v*sqrt(T)))
Theta = dV/dT (time decay per day)
Vega = dV/dv (per 1% IV change)
Rho = dV/dr (per 1% rate change)
```

Strengths:

- Complete sensitivity profile for any position
- Enables hedging: delta-neutral portfolios, gamma scalping
- Theta quantifies time decay cost (or income for sellers)
- Vega captures volatility exposure precisely

Weaknesses:

- Point-in-time estimates: change as underlying moves
- Higher-order Greeks (charm, vanna, volga) not computed
- Assumes continuous hedging (discrete rebalancing in practice)
- Gamma risk amplifies near expiry and at-the-money

Example: An iron condor on SPY: net delta ~0 (market neutral), net theta +\$15/day (time decay income), net vega -\$200 (short volatility). If VIX spikes 5%, vega tells you the position loses ~\$1000.

1.3 Implied Volatility Solver (Brent's Method)

Implied volatility is the market's consensus forecast of future volatility, extracted by inverting the Black-Scholes formula. Since BS has no closed-form inverse for vol, Exon uses Brent's root-finding method (bracketed between 0.1% and 1000% IV) to find the volatility that makes the BS price equal the market price.

```
Find v* such that: BS(S, K, T, v*, r) = Market_Price
```

```
Brent's method: hybrid bisection + secant + inverse quadratic  
interpolation. Guaranteed convergence on [0.001, 10.0].  
Tolerance: 1e-6
```

Strengths:

- Guaranteed convergence (unlike Newton-Raphson which can diverge)
- Super-linear convergence speed in practice
- Robust across all strike/expiry combinations

Weaknesses:

- Slower than Newton-Raphson when derivatives are cheap
- Requires valid bracket [a,b] where $f(a) \cdot f(b) < 0$
- Returns NaN for invalid inputs (arbitrage-violating prices)

Example: MSFT call trading at \$8.50, spot \$420, strike \$425, 45 DTE: Brent solver finds IV = 22.3%. Compare to 30-day realized vol of 18.1% to identify that options are 'expensive' ($IV > RV$), favouring premium-selling strategies.

1.4 Put-Call Parity

A fundamental arbitrage relationship between European call and put prices. Exon uses this as a sanity check: if parity is violated beyond tolerance, something is wrong with the data or pricing.

```
C - P = S - K * exp(-rT)
```

```
Deviation = (C - P) - (S - K*exp(-rT))  
Parity holds if |deviation| <= tolerance * S
```

Strengths:

- Model-free: works regardless of volatility assumptions
- Detects data errors and stale quotes
- Confirms market efficiency in real-time

Weaknesses:

- Only applies to European options (American options have early exercise premium)
- Dividend adjustments needed for equity options
- Bid-ask spreads can cause apparent violations in practice

Example: SPY call at \$12.50, put at \$8.30, spot \$580, strike \$575, 30 DTE, $r=5\%$: Theoretical diff = \$7.35. Actual diff = \$4.20. Deviation = -\$3.15 flags a data issue.

2. Momentum & Trend Models

2.1 Time-Series Momentum (TSMOM)

Based on Moskowitz, Ooi & Pedersen (2012). Measures an asset's own historical return over multiple lookback windows and trades in the direction of the trend. Each window's signal is z-score normalised and combined. Position is volatility-scaled to target a fixed annualised volatility level.

```
Signal_w = (Price_t / Price_{t-w} - 1) for each window w
Z_w = (Signal_w - rolling_mean) / rolling_std
Combined = mean(Z_w for all windows)
Vol_scale = target_vol / realised_vol
Final_position = Combined * Vol_scale
```

Default lookbacks: [24, 72, 168, 336, 720] hours or [5, 21, 63, 126, 252] days

Strengths:

- Academically robust (published factor with decades of evidence)
- Multi-window approach reduces whipsaws from any single lookback
- Volatility scaling equalises risk across assets
- Works across all asset classes

Weaknesses:

- Suffers in choppy/range-bound markets (trend reversals)
- Lagging indicator: enters after move has started
- Crowded trade: many quant funds use momentum
- Volatility scaling can amplify losses in regime changes

Example: BTC 720-hour return = +35%, z-score = 2.1 (strong uptrend). 72-hour return = +8%, z-score = 1.4. Combined = 0.875. Realised vol = 60%, target = 15%, scale = 0.25. Final position: long 22%.

2.2 Cross-Sectional Momentum (XSMOM)

Ranks all assets by their recent return performance and goes long the winners while shorting the losers. Based on Jegadeesh & Titman (1993). Unlike TSMOM which trades an asset against itself, this trades assets against each other.

```
Return_i = Price_i(t) / Price_i(t-lookback) - 1
Rank assets by Return_i
Long top_n, Short bottom_n
Strength = 1 - rank/n * 0.5
```

Default: lookback=63 days, top_n=5, bottom_n=3

Strengths:

- Market-neutral: long-short cancels market beta
- Captures relative value (best vs worst performers)
- Robust across global equities for 200+ years of data

Weaknesses:

- Momentum crashes: sharp reversals destroy short-term gains
- High turnover: frequent rebalancing increases costs
- Works best with large universes (>20 assets)

Example: 15-stock universe: NVDA +28% (rank 1), AAPL +15% (rank 2), ... INTC -12% (rank 14). Long NVDA/AAPL/GOOGL, short INTC/WBA. Winner strength = 1.0, loser = -0.8.

2.3 Adaptive Momentum (Efficiency Ratio)

Combines Kaufman's Efficiency Ratio with volatility regime detection to dynamically adjust the momentum lookback window. In trending markets, uses longer lookbacks; in choppy markets, shortens to reduce whipsaw losses.

```
Efficiency Ratio = |Price_t - Price_{t-n}| / sum(|Price_i - Price_{i-1}|)
```

```
ER -> 1.0: strong trend (price moved directly)
```

```
ER -> 0.0: choppy (lots of back-and-forth)
```

```
Adaptive_lookback = base * (2.0 - ER)
```

```
Confidence boosted when ER > 0.5, penalised when < 0.3
```

Strengths:

- Adapts to market conditions automatically
- Reduces whipsaws in choppy markets
- No regime detection model needed (self-adjusting)

Weaknesses:

- More parameters to tune than simple momentum
- Lag in adapting to sudden regime shifts
- Harder to backtest: path-dependent lookback changes

Example: SPY with ER=0.72 (strong uptrend): lookback shortens, confidence boosted 1.3x. Next month ER drops to 0.15 (choppy): lookback extends, confidence cut to 0.5x.

2.4 Sector Rotation (12-1 Month Momentum)

Ranks sector ETFs by 12-month return skipping the most recent month (to avoid short-term reversal). Combines absolute momentum, relative strength vs SPY, and a mean-reversion penalty.

```
Momentum_12_1 = Return(12 months) - Return(1 month)
```

```
Risk_adj = Momentum / Volatility(63 days)
```

```
Rel_strength = Momentum - SPY_Momentum
```

```
MR_penalty = -abs(1-month z-score) * 0.3
```

```
Score = 0.4*risk_adj + 0.35*rel_strength + 0.25*MR_penalty
```

```
Long top 3 sectors, short bottom 2
```

Strengths:

- Documented factor (Moskowitz & Grinblatt 1999)
- Skipping recent month avoids short-term reversal
- Low turnover: monthly rebalancing only

Weaknesses:

- Sector ETFs have higher correlation than individual stocks
- Factor crowding risk
- Underperforms in sector-correlated sell-offs

Example: XLK (tech) 12M return +32%, skip month -2%, score = +30%. XLE (energy) -8%, score = -13%. Long XLK/XLY/XLF, short XLE/XLU.

3. Mean-Reversion Models

3.1 Bollinger Band Mean Reversion

Trades deviations from a rolling moving average, entering when price reaches the outer Bollinger Bands. Position size scales with degree of overshoot. Dynamic band width adjusts to volatility regime.

```
MA = rolling_mean(price, window=21)
Std = rolling_std(price, window=21)
Z = (price - MA) / Std

Entry: |Z| > entry_std (default 2.0)
Exit: |Z| < exit_std (default 0.5)
Direction: short if Z > 0, long if Z < 0
Strength = min((|Z| - entry) / entry, 1.0)
```

Strengths:

- Simple and intuitive
- Dynamic bands adapt to current volatility
- Clear entry/exit rules reduce discretion

Weaknesses:

- Fails catastrophically in trends (price stays outside bands)
- Z-score assumes normal distribution (fat tails break this)
- No theoretical basis for band width choice

Example: MSFT trades at \$420, 21-day MA = \$410, std = \$8. $Z = 1.25$ (not yet at entry). Price spikes to \$430: $Z = 2.5$, enter short. Reverts to \$415: close for ~\$15/share.

3.2 Ornstein-Uhlenbeck (OU) Process

A continuous-time mean-reverting stochastic process. Exon estimates OU parameters from discrete data via OLS regression on lagged values. The half-life determines trade horizon.

```
dx = theta * (mu - X) * dt + sigma * dw

Discrete estimation:
dx_t = a + b * x_{t-1} (OLS regression)
theta = -b (mean reversion speed)
mu = -a / b (long-run mean)
half_life = ln(2) / theta

Filter: min_half_life <= half_life <= max_half_life
```

Strengths:

- Theoretically grounded continuous-time stochastic process
- Half-life gives objective trade horizon
- Natural filter: rejects assets that don't mean-revert

Weaknesses:

- Assumes stationary process (breaks in trending markets)
- Parameter estimation sensitive to window length
- Small sample sizes produce unreliable estimates

Example: BTC-ETH spread has half-life = 18 hours. Current deviation: 2.3 sigma above mean. OU predicts reversion within 36 hours. Short the spread, exit when z-score drops below 0.5.

3.3 Pairs Trading (Engle-Granger Cointegration)

Tests if two price series share a long-run equilibrium (cointegration). If cointegrated, the spread is stationary and mean-reverting. Exon scans all pairs and ranks by cointegration strength.

```
Step 1: Engle-Granger test
Y = alpha + beta * X + epsilon
Test epsilon for stationarity (ADF test)

Step 2: Spread = Y - beta * X - alpha

Step 3: Z-score trading
Z = (Spread - mean) / std
Long if Z < -entry, Short if Z > +entry

Half-life via AR(1): half_life = -ln(2) / ln(phi)
```

Strengths:

- Statistically rigorous cointegration test
- Market-neutral: dollar-neutral long-short pairs
- Mean-reversion empirically validated for cointegrated pairs

Weaknesses:

- Cointegration can break down (structural changes)
- Hedge ratio estimation error introduces drift
- Requires sufficient history for reliable testing

Example: KO and PEP test cointegrated ($p=0.02$). Hedge ratio $\beta=0.85$. Spread z-score hits -2.5: long 100 KO, short 85 PEP. Reverts over 2 weeks for \$320 profit.

4. Statistical & Signal Processing Models

4.1 Kalman Filter (State-Space Model)

A recursive Bayesian estimator for tracking a time-varying hedge ratio in pairs trading. Unlike static OLS, the Kalman filter adapts the hedge ratio in real-time. The innovation z-score serves as the trading signal.

```
State: theta_t = theta_{t-1} + w_t, w ~ N(0, Q)
Obs: y_t = [1, x_t] * theta_t + v_t, v ~ N(0, R)

Predict: theta_pred = theta_{t-1}, P_pred = P_{t-1} + Q
Update:
innovation = y_t - H * theta_pred
S = H * P_pred * H' + R
K = P_pred * H' / S (Kalman gain)
theta_t = theta_pred + K * innovation

Signal = innovation / sqrt(S)
```

Strengths:

- Adaptive: hedge ratio updates every bar
- Handles non-stationary relationships
- Provides uncertainty estimate (covariance P)
- Optimal estimator for linear-Gaussian systems

Weaknesses:

- Sensitive to noise parameters Q and R
- Assumes linear relationship
- Can overfit to noise if Q is too large

Example: Tracking BTC-ETH hedge ratio: static OLS says $\beta=15.2$, Kalman tracks it from 14.8 to 15.7 over 30 days. Innovation z-score = -2.8: long the spread, close at $z=0$ for \$450 profit.

4.2 Discrete Wavelet Transform (DWT)

Decomposes price returns into different frequency components using Haar wavelets. Each level captures a different time-scale. Momentum is computed per scale and combined with frequency-dependent weights.

```
Haar wavelet decomposition (5 levels):
D1: 2-4 hour cycles (noise)
D2: 4-8 hour cycles (intraday)
D3: 8-16 hour cycles (session-level)
D4: 16-32 hour cycles (multi-day)
D5: 32-64 hour cycles (weekly)
A5: 64+ hours (macro trend)

Weights: higher for lower frequencies (macro > noise)
```

Strengths:

- Separates signal from noise at each time-scale
- Captures multi-timeframe momentum simultaneously
- No look-ahead bias (causal decomposition)

Weaknesses:

- Haar wavelet is simplest (may miss smoother patterns)
- Boundary effects at start/end of data
- Weight selection across scales is subjective

Example: BTC returns: D1 (noise) random, D4 (multi-day) strong uptrend +0.7, A5 (macro) +0.4. Combined with D4/A5 weighted 2x, D1 at 0.5x. Net momentum: +0.55, go long.

4.3 Hurst Exponent (Rescaled Range Analysis)

Measures long-range dependence structure of a time series. Determines whether a series is trending ($H > 0.5$), random walk ($H = 0.5$), or mean-reverting ($H < 0.5$). Used as a regime filter.

```
For each lag L:
1. Divide series into blocks of size L
2. R = max(cumsum) - min(cumsum) of deviations
3. S = std(block)
4. Average R/S across blocks

Hurst H = slope of log(R/S) vs log(L)
H < 0.5: mean-reverting | H = 0.5: random | H > 0.5: trending
```

Strengths:

- Non-parametric: no distribution assumptions
- Captures long-memory effects
- Natural strategy selector: trend vs mean-revert

Weaknesses:

- Sensitive to data length (needs 100+ observations)
- R/S method has upward bias for small samples
- Binary threshold choice is arbitrary

Example: AAPL 63-day Hurst = 0.62 (trending): enable momentum, disable mean-reversion. Next quarter Hurst = 0.38 (mean-reverting): switch to Bollinger/OU strategies.

4.4 Principal Component Analysis (PCA)

Decomposes asset returns into orthogonal factors. PC1 is typically the market factor. Residuals represent idiosyncratic alpha. PCA-based stat arb trades residuals back to zero.

```
Z = (X - mean) / std (standardise)
PCA: Z = U * S * V' (SVD)
Factor returns = Z * V[:, :k]
Residuals = Z - Reconstructed

Variance threshold: select k s.t. cum_var >= 90%
Trading signal: z-score of cumulative residual
```

Strengths:

- Data-driven: discovers structure without assumptions
- Removes systematic risk (market, sector factors)
- Residuals are uncorrelated (clean alpha signals)

Weaknesses:

- Components have no economic interpretation a priori
- Sensitive to outliers
- Number of components must be chosen

Example: 15-stock universe: PC1 explains 62% variance (market). NVDA residual = +3.2 sigma. Short NVDA residual, expecting reversion. 2 weeks later, residual returns to 0.

5. Regime Detection & Factor Models

5.1 Gaussian Mixture Model (GMM)

Clusters market conditions into discrete regimes (low-vol trending, normal, high-vol crisis) using unsupervised ML. Features include return level, volatility, and momentum. Drives dynamic strategy allocation. Uses scikit-learn's GaussianMixture.

```
Features F = [return, volatility, momentum]
GMM: P(x) = sum_k( pi_k * N(x | mu_k, Sigma_k) )
k = 3 regimes, full covariance, EM algorithm

Regime allocation multipliers:
Regime 0 (trending): momentum 1.5x, MR 0.5x
Regime 1 (normal): momentum 1.0x, MR 1.2x
Regime 2 (high vol): momentum 0.5x, breakout 1.5x
```

Strengths:

- Discovers regimes without pre-specifying rules
- Soft clustering: provides probabilities
- Enables dynamic strategy allocation (core RenTech insight)

Weaknesses:

- Number of regimes must be pre-specified
- Initialisation-dependent (local optima)
- Regime labels can swap between refits

Example: SPY: return=+0.1%, vol=12%, mom=+5%. GMM: 70% regime 0 (trending). Allocator boosts momentum 1.5x, reduces mean-reversion 0.5x.

5.2 Multi-Factor Model (IC-Weighted)

Ranks assets on 6 orthogonal factors and combines using Information Coefficient (IC) adaptive weighting. IC = Spearman rank correlation between factor and subsequent returns.

```
Six factors (cross-sectional z-scored):
1. Momentum: blended [72, 168, 336] windows
2. Short-term reversal: -return(12h)
3. Volatility: -std (low-vol anomaly)
4. Liquidity: -avg(|return|)
5. Autocorrelation: lag-1 correlation
6. Skewness: -skew

IC = Spearman(factor_rank, forward_returns)
Weight_i = IC_i / sum(|IC_j|)
```

Strengths:

- Diversified alpha: 6 independent return drivers
- Adaptive: IC weighting increases profitable factor exposure
- Self-correcting: declining IC reduces factor allocation

Weaknesses:

- Many parameters to tune
- IC estimation noisy on short windows
- Factor correlations change over time

Example: NVDA: momentum z=+1.8, reversal z=-0.3, low_vol z=-1.2. Recent ICs: momentum=0.08, reversal=0.12. IC-weighted composite = +0.37. Ranks 2nd: long with strength 0.8.

5.3 Post-Earnings Announcement Drift (PEAD)

Detects earnings-like events via abnormal price gaps and trades continuation drift. Academically documented: stocks that gap up on earnings continue drifting up for 60 days.

```
Event detection:
baseline_vol = std(returns excl. event window)
z_score = max(|return|) / baseline_vol
Trigger if z > gap_threshold (default 2.5)

Drift signal:
decay = 0.95 ^ bars_since_event
direction = sign(event_return)
strength = min(z/5, 1.0) * decay
```

Strengths:

- Strong academic evidence (60+ years of drift)
- High conviction: event-driven with clear catalyst
- Exponential decay naturally reduces position

Weaknesses:

- Proxy detection: not all gaps are earnings
- Drift may have decayed in recent years
- Limited opportunities: only when gaps occur

Example: AAPL gaps up 4.5% on earnings. $Z = 3.75$. Initial strength 0.75. Day 20: strength = $0.75 * 0.95^{20} = 0.27$. Position slowly unwound.

5.4 Market Microstructure (OBV & A/D Line)

Analyses volume patterns to detect institutional accumulation or distribution before price moves. Combines OBV trend, A/D line, and relative volume.

```
OBV = cumsum( sign(return) * volume )
OBV_trend = slope(OBV, window) / std(OBV)

A/D = cumsum( CLV * volume )
CLV = (2*close - high - low) / (high - low)

RVOL = volume / rolling_mean(volume, 63d)
Signal = OBV_trend * RVOL_boost
```

Strengths:

- Leading indicator: volume precedes price
- Detects institutional activity
- RVOL confirmation reduces false signals

Weaknesses:

- Volume data not always available
- Falls back to price-only proxy (less accurate)
- Divergences can persist longer than expected

Example: GOOGL: price flat, OBV trending up for 2 weeks ($z=2.1$). $RVOL=1.8$. Accumulation signal: long GOOGL. Price breaks out to \$185.

6. Portfolio Optimisation Models

6.1 Mean-Variance Optimisation (Markowitz)

Harry Markowitz's 1952 framework: maximise expected return for given risk. Uses quadratic programming with risk aversion parameter gamma.

```
Maximise: w'*mu - (gamma/2) * w'*Sigma*w
Subject to: sum(w_i) = 1, |w_i| <= max_weight
Solver: scipy SLSQP
gamma = risk aversion (default 1.0)
```

Strengths:

- Theoretically optimal for quadratic utility
- Considers correlations (diversification benefit)
- Industry standard for institutional allocation

Weaknesses:

- Sensitive to input estimation errors ('error maximiser')
- Concentrated portfolios from small covariance perturbations
- Assumes normally distributed returns

Example: 5-asset portfolio: gamma=1.0 gives [15%, 20%, 10%, 20%, 15%] with Sharpe 1.8. Gamma=3.0 gives more diversified [18%, 15%, 20%, 18%, 19%] with Sharpe 1.5.

6.2 Risk Parity

Allocates capital so each asset contributes equally to total portfolio risk. Ignores expected returns and focuses purely on risk diversification.

```
Portfolio var: sigma_p^2 = w' * Sigma * w
Marginal risk: MR_i = (Sigma @ w)_i
Risk contribution: RC_i = w_i * MR_i / sigma_p

Objective: minimise sum( (RC_i/sum(RC) - 1/N)^2 )
Constraint: w_i >= 0
```

Strengths:

- No return estimates needed (avoids estimation error)
- True diversification by risk, not capital
- Robust and less sensitive to input perturbations

Weaknesses:

- Ignores expected returns (may allocate to poor assets)
- Tends to overweight low-vol assets
- Implicitly assumes equal Sharpe ratios

Example: AAPL (vol=25%), TLT (vol=12%), GLD (vol=15%). Equal capital = 33% each, but AAPL contributes 52% risk. Risk parity: AAPL 19%, TLT 42%, GLD 39%.

6.3 Kelly Criterion

Optimal bet sizing that maximises long-run geometric growth rate. Exon uses fractional Kelly (default 25%) for safety.

```
Full Kelly:  $w = \Sigma^{-1} @ \mu$   
Fractional Kelly:  $w_{frac} = 0.25 * w_{full}$   
Max weight: clipped to +/- 0.25  
Normalised to  $\sum(|w|) = 1$ 
```

Strengths:

- Maximises long-run wealth growth (theoretically optimal)
- Naturally sizes bigger on high-Sharpe opportunities
- Fractional Kelly reduces drawdown risk

Weaknesses:

- Full Kelly is extremely aggressive
- Requires accurate return/covariance estimates
- Sensitive to estimation error

Example: Strategy with $E[r]=15\%$, $vol=20\%$: Full Kelly = 3.75x leverage. Quarter Kelly = 0.94x. Kelly allocates more to NVDA (Sharpe 1.2, 30%) vs INTC (Sharpe 0.3, 8%).

7. Risk Management Models

7.1 Value at Risk (VaR) & Expected Shortfall (CVaR)

VaR measures worst expected loss at a given confidence level. CVaR measures average loss in the worst cases beyond VaR. Both are portfolio risk constraints in Exon.

```
VaR_95 = percentile(portfolio_returns, 5th)
VaR_99 = percentile(portfolio_returns, 1st)
CVaR = mean(returns where returns <= VaR_95)

Constraint: |VaR_95| <= 2% of portfolio
If breached: reduce exposure proportionally
```

Strengths:

- Industry standard risk metric (Basel III)
- CVaR captures tail risk beyond VaR
- Historical method: no distribution assumptions

Weaknesses:

- Historical VaR assumes past distribution continues
- VaR is not sub-additive
- Short history underestimates tail risk

Example: 10-stock portfolio, 252 days. VaR_95 = -1.8%, CVaR = -3.2%. If VaR exceeds 2% limit, reduce all positions by VaR/limit ratio.

7.2 Volatility Targeting

Scales position size to target specific annualised volatility. If realised vol rises, position is reduced to maintain constant risk.

```
realised_vol = std(returns, lookback) * sqrt(bars_per_year)
scale = target_vol / realised_vol
adjusted_position = raw_position * min(scale, max_scale)

Default: target_vol = 10-15% annualised
```

Strengths:

- Equalises risk across assets with different volatilities
- Automatically de-levers in volatile markets
- Simple and effective: used by most quant funds

Weaknesses:

- Backward-looking: uses past vol for future sizing
- Lag in responding to sudden vol spikes
- Can force exit at worst time (selling during crash)

Example: BTC vol=60%, target=15%: scale=0.25, hold 25%. AAPL vol=20%, target=15%: scale=0.75, hold 75%. Both contribute ~15% vol.

7.3 Drawdown Circuit Breaker

Automatically reduces portfolio exposure when drawdown from peak exceeds threshold. Prevents catastrophic losses by progressive de-leveraging.

```
peak_equity = max(equity_curve)
drawdown = (current - peak) / peak

If drawdown < -max_dd_pct:
    reduction = max_dd / drawdown
    weights *= reduction

Default: max_dd_pct = 15%, min_cash = 5%
```

Strengths:

- Prevents ruin: caps maximum loss from peak
- Automatic: no discretionary intervention needed
- Progressive: proportional to drawdown depth

Weaknesses:

- Pro-cyclical: sells into falling markets
- Can prevent recovery (reduced positions miss rebound)
- Frequent triggering creates whipsaw

Example: Portfolio peaks at \$120K, falls to \$100K (dd=-16.7%). Breaches 15%. Reduction = 0.90. All positions scaled 0.90x.

8. Backtesting & Validation

8.1 Walk-Forward Analysis

Rolling out-of-sample testing that avoids overfitting. Strategy is trained on each window and tested on subsequent unseen data. Results aggregated across all out-of-sample windows.

```
For each window i:  
Train: data[start : start + train_size]  
Test: data[start + train : start + train + test_size]  
Step: start += step  
  
Equities: train=252d, test=63d, step=63d  
Crypto: train=720h, test=168h, step=168h  
  
Metrics: mean Sharpe, % positive windows, worst DD
```

Strengths:

- True out-of-sample testing (no look-ahead bias)
- Detects overfitting: must work on unseen data
- Multiple windows give statistical significance

Weaknesses:

- Reduces total test data
- Short test windows have noisy estimates
- Doesn't capture all regimes in each window

Example: 2 years daily data: 4 out-of-sample windows. Mean Sharpe 1.2 (consistent). One window -0.5 signals regime sensitivity. 75% positive Sharpe.

8.2 Monte Carlo Sharpe Significance Test

Bootstrap hypothesis test: is the Sharpe ratio statistically significant or from random chance? Shuffles returns to destroy signal and computes null distribution.

```
1. Compute actual_sharpe from real returns  
2. For i in 1..10000:  
  - Shuffle returns (destroy temporal structure)  
  - Compute null_sharpe_i  
3. p_value = fraction(null_sharpes >= actual_sharpe)  
  
Significant if p < 0.05
```

Strengths:

- Non-parametric: no distribution assumptions
- Directly answers: 'is this Sharpe real or luck?'
- Accounts for return characteristics (kurtosis, skew)

Weaknesses:

- Computationally expensive (10K permutations)
- Destroys autocorrelation (may overstate significance for momentum)
- Doesn't account for multiple testing

Example: Strategy Sharpe=2.1. After 10K shuffles, null mean=0.01, std=0.35. p=0.001 (highly significant, not luck).

8.3 Options Backtesting Engine

Specialised backtester for options: Black-Scholes repricing, daily Greeks tracking, IV path simulation with mean-reverting dynamics, expiry settlement, and position lifecycle management.

```
IV simulation (per asset, per day):
IV_t = IV_{t-1} + k*(RV*1.1 - IV_{t-1}) + s_v*noise
k=0.03 (mean reversion), s_v=0.01 (vol of vol)

Daily mark-to-market:
price = BS(spot_t, strike, DTE_t, IV_t)
Greeks = compute_greeks(...)

Expiry: max(spot-strike, 0) for calls * multiplier
```

Strengths:

- Realistic: theta decay, IV changes, gamma all modelled
- Greeks tracking enables risk-aware development
- Handles multi-leg structures (spreads, condors)

Weaknesses:

- Simulated IV paths are approximations
- No volatility smile modelling (flat IV)
- No early exercise (European-style only)

Example: Momentum on AAPL -> bull call spread (high IV). Buy 150C, sell 155C, debit \$2.50. Over 30 days: spot +\$8, IV -3%. BS reprice: spread \$4.20. Profit \$1.70/contract.

9. Machine Learning Models (Available)

XGBoost and LightGBM are included as optional dependencies for future strategy development. They are gradient boosting frameworks commonly used in quantitative finance for return prediction, feature importance, and non-linear signal combination.

9.1 XGBoost (eXtreme Gradient Boosting)

A gradient boosting ensemble by Tianqi Chen (2016). Builds additive decision trees where each tree corrects errors of the ensemble. Widely used in quant finance for return prediction, alpha combination, and regime classification.

```
Objective: min sum(L(y_i, y_hat_i)) + sum(Omega(f_k))
L = loss (MSE or logloss)
Omega = regularisation (tree complexity)

y_hat^(t) = y_hat^(t-1) + eta * f_t(x_i)
f_t = tree fitted to negative gradient of loss

Key params: max_depth(3-8), n_estimators(100-1000),
learning_rate(0.01-0.1), subsample, colsample_bytree
```

Strengths:

- Handles non-linear feature interactions automatically
- Built-in regularisation prevents overfitting
- Feature importance identifies useful signals
- Handles missing data natively
- Fast training with GPU support

Weaknesses:

- Black box: hard to interpret predictions
- Prone to overfitting on financial data (low SNR)
- Requires careful time-series cross-validation
- Feature engineering still required
- Non-stationary markets violate i.i.d. assumption

Example: Features: [momentum_5d, vol_ratio, OBV_z, RSI, IV_rank]. Target: 5-day return direction. XGBClassifier(max_depth=4, n_estimators=200). Walk-forward accuracy: 54% (profitable after costs if consistent).

9.2 LightGBM (Light Gradient Boosting Machine)

Microsoft's gradient boosting framework (2017), optimised for speed and memory. Uses leaf-wise tree growth, histogram binning, and GOSS (Gradient-based One-Side Sampling) for faster training on large datasets.

Key differences from XGBoost:

1. Leaf-wise growth (vs level-wise): faster convergence
2. Histogram binning: reduces memory and split time
3. GOSS: keeps large-gradient instances, downsamples small
4. EFB: bundles mutually exclusive features

Key params: `num_leaves(31)`, `learning_rate`,
`n_estimators`, `min_data_in_leaf`, `feature_fraction`

Strengths:

- 10-20x faster training than XGBoost on large data
- Lower memory usage (histogram-based)
- Native categorical feature support
- Often higher accuracy with less tuning

Weaknesses:

- Leaf-wise growth overfits more on small datasets
- Same fundamental limitations as all boosting
- Histogram binning loses precision for continuous features
- Requires careful `num_leaves` tuning

Example: Same features, 10 years hourly data (87,600 samples). LightGBM trains in 12s vs XGBoost 180s. LGBMRegressor predicts next-day returns. Walk-forward IC = 0.04 (small but consistent alpha).

10. IV Surface & Volatility Models

10.1 IV Rank & IV Percentile

Two measures of where current IV sits relative to history. IV Rank uses min/max, IV Percentile counts observations below current. Both drive the signal-to-options structure mapping.

```
IV Rank = (current_IV - 52wk_low) / (52wk_high - 52wk_low)
IV Percentile = count(historical_IV < current) / N
```

Classification:

IV < 30th pctile: LOW (buy premium)

IV 30-70th pctile: NORMAL

IV > 70th pctile: HIGH (sell premium)

Strengths:

- Simple and interpretable
- Historical context for current IV level
- Direct mapping to trading strategy

Weaknesses:

- Backward-looking: past range may not predict future
- IV Rank distorted by single extreme spike
- Doesn't capture term structure or skew

Example: AAPL ATM IV=28%, 52wk range 18%-45%. IV Rank=37% (low-normal). IV Percentile=42%. For bullish signal: select bull call spread.

10.2 Variance Risk Premium (VRP)

The difference between implied and realised volatility. Persistently positive VRP means options are systematically overpriced, creating a structural edge for premium sellers.

```
VRP = IV - RV
```

Realised Vol: $RV = \text{std}(\text{returns}, \text{window}) * \text{sqrt}(252)$

Multi-window: 5d, 21d, 63d

EWMA: exponentially weighted (recent emphasis)

```
IV Proxy: max(rv_5d, rv_21d, rv_63d, ewma) * 1.1
```

VRP > 0: options expensive (sell premium)

VRP < 0: options cheap (buy premium, rare)

Strengths:

- Well-documented structural premium
- Positive VRP = long-run edge for sellers
- Multiple RV windows capture different regimes

Weaknesses:

- VRP can go negative during crises
- Selling vol has tail risk (earned slowly, lost fast)
- IV proxy is approximate without live data

Example: SPY IV=22%, 21d RV=15%. VRP=+7% (options expensive). Iron condor has structural edge. But March 2020: VRP=-30%. Use defined-risk structures.

10.3 Signal-to-Options Structure Mapping

The core decision engine mapping equity signals (direction + strength) and IV regime into 12 options structures. Bridges equity strategy layer to options execution.

```
Strong bullish + Low IV -> Long call
Strong bullish + High IV -> Bull call spread
Strong bearish + Low IV -> Long put
Strong bearish + High IV -> Bear put spread
Weak signal + High IV -> Iron condor
Weak signal + Low IV -> Long strangle
Breakout + Low IV -> Long straddle
Mean-reversion + High IV -> Short strangle
Medium bull + High IV -> Bull put spread
Medium bear + High IV -> Bear call spread
```

```
Conviction: strong > 0.6, weak < 0.25
```

Strengths:

- Systematic: removes emotional bias
- IV-regime-aware: buys cheap, sells expensive
- 12 structures cover all views

Weaknesses:

- Simplified: real traders consider more factors
- Fixed thresholds may not suit all conditions
- No individual Greek limits per structure

Example: MSFT signal: direction=+0.8, strength=0.7 (strong bullish). IV pctile=75% (high). Mapper: bull call spread. Buy 420C, sell 440C, 45 DTE. Max loss \$5.50, max gain \$14.50. Risk-reward 2.6:1.

Appendix: Model Summary Table

Model	Category	Primary Use	Source File
Black-Scholes	Options Pricing	Mark-to-market, premium	options/pricing.py
Greeks (d/g/t/v/r)	Options Risk	Sensitivity analysis	options/pricing.py
Implied Vol (Brent)	Options Pricing	IV extraction	options/pricing.py
Put-Call Parity	Options Validation	Data quality check	options/pricing.py
Time-Series Momentum	Trend Following	Directional trading	strategies/momentum.py
Cross-Sectional Mom.	Relative Value	Long-short ranking	strategies/momentum.py
Adaptive Momentum	Trend Following	Regime-adaptive	strategies/momentum.py
Sector Rotation	Factor Rotation	Sector ETF allocation	strategies/sector_rot.py
Bollinger Mean Rev.	Mean Reversion	Range-bound trading	strategies/mean_rev.py
Ornstein-Uhlenbeck	Mean Reversion	Half-life estimation	strategies/mean_rev.py
Engle-Granger	Pairs Trading	Spread trading	research/coint.py
Kalman Filter	State-Space	Dynamic hedge ratios	strategies/kalman.py
Wavelet DWT	Signal Processing	Multi-scale momentum	strategies/wavelet.py
Hurst Exponent	Regime Detection	Trend/MR filter	strategies/hurst.py
PCA	Factor Model	Systematic risk removal	research/pca.py
GMM	Regime Detection	Market regime cluster	research/regime.py
Multi-Factor (IC)	Factor Model	Cross-sect. alpha	strategies/multifactor.py
PEAD	Event-Driven	Earnings drift	strategies/earnings.py
OBV / A-D Line	Microstructure	Volume flow	strategies/micro.py
Mean-Variance	Portfolio Opt.	Optimal allocation	portfolio/optimizer.py
Risk Parity	Portfolio Opt.	Equal risk alloc.	portfolio/optimizer.py
Kelly Criterion	Position Sizing	Growth-optimal	portfolio/optimizer.py
VaR / CVaR	Risk Mgmt	Tail risk monitoring	risk/manager.py
Vol Targeting	Risk Mgmt	Risk normalisation	risk/manager.py
Walk-Forward	Validation	OOS testing	backtest/engine.py
Monte Carlo Sharpe	Validation	Significance test	backtest/metrics.py
IV Rank/Percentile	Vol Analysis	IV regime class.	options/vol_surface.py
Variance Risk Prem.	Vol Analysis	Premium edge	options/vol_surface.py
Signal-Structure Map	Options Strategy	Structure select	options/strat_mapper.py
XGBoost	Machine Learning	Return prediction	pyproject.toml (dep)
LightGBM	Machine Learning	Fast boosting	pyproject.toml (dep)

This document covers 31 quantitative models implemented across the Exon Research platform. All models are backtested with walk-forward validation and Monte Carlo significance testing. The platform runs 260 automated tests across equity, crypto, and options modules. XGBoost and LightGBM are available as optional dependencies for ML-based strategy development.